

Migration, Networks, and Religious Choice*

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Abstract

Abstract: Over the last half century, affiliation to Pentecostal denominations has grown rapidly, with most of this growth concentrated in developing countries. This paper investigates one economic factor influencing this growth - rural-urban migration. Religious institutions attract members by serving as hosts for economic and social networks, a service which is especially attractive for migrants into the city. I present new evidence from Ghana to test this hypothesis, using data from the ISSER Northwestern-Yale Panel Survey (GSPS) and a collected survey of Pentecostal churches in Accra. I construct a series of shift-share instruments for migration, using exposure to price shocks in the mining, construction and manufacturing industries, finding a significant effect of migration on Pentecostal affiliation. I present data that Pentecostal churches in urban areas offer more network services, and that migrants with fewer connections are more likely to attend these churches. The process of migration also has implications for village networks. I find that out-migration induces conversion for households at the origin, who convert away from Catholicism towards Protestantism. I present evidence consistent with the story that out-migrant households convert in response to weakening ties with the village network.

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Across the last century, there have been monumental shifts in the patterns of religious affiliation around the globe. In contrast to a steadily secularising West, religiosity in much of the developing world is climbing. One trend embedded in this transition is the rapid rise of new Christian Pentecostal denominations, especially within Africa and Latin America, rising from a near zero share in 1900 to 8% of the global population today (World Christian Database, 2024). These Pentecostal denominations dispense with many of the rituals and the formality found within the mainline Catholic and Protestant denominations. Critical to understanding the forces that underlie this trend, is understanding the good (in the economic sense) that Pentecostal churches are providing, and why this good might be especially valuable in a low income, rapidly urbanising context.

One service that Pentecostal churches, and religious institutions broadly, provide is by serving as hosts for social and economic networks. Religious institutions provide a space, and an opportunity, for a group of people to socialise and build trust with one another through repeat interactions. Compared to other common networks, religious networks are not explicitly discriminatory - any individual has the opportunity to join, and are often encouraged to do so. Furthermore, religious institutions provide unique opportunities to socialise across demographic groups (Chetty et al., 2022).

Centralisation of network services may be especially important in urban areas, where the environment is rapidly changing, and there are confluences of many disparate groups of people. We know that networks can be critical for migrants, assisting in the process of integration into a new economic environment (Beaman, 2012; Dai et al., 2019), assisting both with risk mitigation, and providing a pathway to employment. As the process of urbanisation draws people into the city, the services provided by religious institutions will be especially valuable for migrants, inducing changes in religious affiliation as migrants access the network.

Migration and urbanisation may, therefore, play a central role in shaping patterns of religious affiliation over time. If Pentecostal churches are especially successful at facilitating economic networks, they may gain an advantage in cities as migrants convert.

The hypothesis I explore in this paper is the following: Rural-Urban migration is an important factor in the growth of Pentecostalism, owing to the comparative advantage Pentecostal

churches hold in facilitating economic and social networks.

An effective network host is one that provides centralised, credible and timely services to their members, and extracts contributions fairly and effectively. Institutions that by nature are participatory, flexible, trustworthy and hold lower levels of bureaucracy will be most effective at fulfilling this role.

1 Data

1.1 Stylised Facts

2 Empirical Framework

In this section I seek to establish that migrants, who value network services, convert upon migrating, and convert towards Pentecostal denominations.

For individual i in community d at period t , the effect of migration on affiliation to Religion Rel is estimated with

$$Rel_{idt} = \beta_R Rel_{i,birth} + \beta_M Mig_{idt} + \beta_X X_{idt} + \alpha_d + \alpha_t + \varepsilon_{idt}$$

where Rel_{idt} is a dummy variable which equals 1 if individual i belongs to religion Rel at time t , $Rel_{i,birth}$ is the religion of individual i at birth, Mig_{idt} is a dummy variable which takes the value of 1 if individual i migrated between periods $t - 1$ and t , α_d is the fixed effect for the community at time 0, and α_t is the time fixed effect.

This estimation compares migrants with non-migrants from the same community at the baseline period, holding fixed individual characteristics in X_{idt} .

However, migration may be endogenous to religious choice for several reasons. There may be selection issues in that individuals who are migrants are also more likely to be Pentecostal. For example, migration will be endogenous if younger people are both more likely to demand the services provided by Pentecostal churches and to migrate to the city. Reverse causality would be a problem if conversion assists in the process of migration, if, for example, joining a Pentecostal church connected you to an inter-district network of churches. Finally, there may be unobserved variables that are correlated with both religious affiliation and migration choices. Several papers (Chen, 2010; Ager and Ciccone, 2018; Buser, 2015) have demonstrated that negative income shocks are likely to increase religiosity. Since income shocks will also affect migration choices, migration will be endogenous if there is no control for these shocks.

2.1 Instrument Design

To address these endogeneity concerns, I construct a set of pull instruments using as-good-as-random shocks to industries at potential destination districts. The instrument z_{iotk} represents

the exposure of individual i from origin district $o \in \Theta$ at time t to price shocks in commodity k in each potential destination district d . This is a market access style shift-share, where individuals who live closer to districts with high employment potential in industry k are more exposed to price shocks that affect that industry. The instrument is constructed as

$$z_{iotk} = \phi_{i(t-1)} \sum_{d \in \Theta/o} \frac{\Delta Price_{kt} \times exposure_{kd}}{\tau_{od}}$$

$\Delta Price_{kt}$ is the sum of price innovations between wave $t - 1$ and wave t , $exposure_{kd}$ is the proportion of workers in industry k that reside in district d at baseline (constructed using the 2010 Ghana Census), τ_{od} is the distance between the centroids of district o and d , and $\phi_{i(t-1)}$ is a measure of potential individual productivity.

$$\phi_{i(t-1)} = yearsedu_{i,0} \times ageweight_{i,t-1}$$

where $yearsedu_{i,0}$ is the years of education for individual i at time 0 and $ageweight_{i,t-1}$ is a measure of the likelihood of migration based on the age of the migrant at time $t - 1$, constructed using the 2010 census.

2.2 Instrument Relevance

I exploit random price innovations which affect employment opportunities in one largely rural industry - gold mining, and two urban industries - construction and manufacturing. In 2022, gold made up 47.7% of total exports in Ghana. Work in small scale and artisanal mines is extensive (the number of people working informally in small mines is estimated to be around 1.1 million, McQuilken and Hilson (2016)). Changes in the global price of gold impacts the profitability of seeking work in gold mining. This in turn induces migration, where households living nearby will be more likely to migrate following this shock. As descriptive evidence for this effect, I regress the share of individuals who report immigrating in a particular year into a gold mining district, according to the 2021 census, on lagged changes in the global gold price series from the FRED database. Results are reported in table 1, and the comovement of series can be seen in figure 1.

	Dependent variable:		
	Prop. of Migrants (1)	Number of In-Migrants (2)	(3)
Gold Price (USD)/1000	0.0001*** (0.00004)	22.045*** (1.699)	
Innovation			0.018*** (0.004)
lag(Innovation)			0.013*** (0.004)
District FE	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	734	734	749
Adjusted R ²	0.467	0.274	0.125
F Statistic	38.835***	17.299***	6.942***

Table 1: Migrants are Adult Males. Regression is at the year-district level.

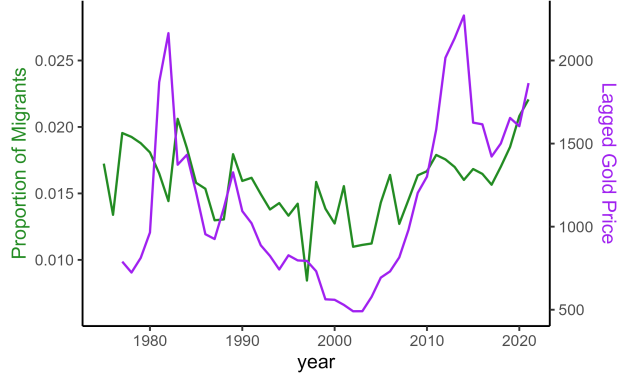


Figure 1: Caption

Secondly I use innovations in the price of construction input (FRED, 2024) multiplied by the US dollar-Ghanaian cedi exchange rate. The construction industry makes up approximately 15% of GDP in Ghana, and employs approximately 420,000 people, especially in urban areas (International Trade Administration, 2023). While approximately 7.9

Thirdly, I use innovations in the price of manufacturing inputs relative to export prices, following the analysis of Kose and Riezman (2001) in examining the effect of trade shocks in Africa. Manufacturing amounts to approximately 11

As in Madhock et al. 2024, I interact the instrument with a measure of individual productivity. The use of this second share exploits individual variation in exposure to the industry shocks. Individuals who are in their early 20s, and who have received more education are more mobile, and therefore are more exposed to the pull-migration shocks.

The two stage least squares framework is the following,

$$Rel_{ioidt} = \beta_R Rel_{i,birth} + \beta_M Mig_{ioidt} + \sum_k exp_{otk} + \beta_X X_{idt} + \alpha_o + \alpha_t + \varepsilon_{idt}$$

$$M_{iodt} = \beta_R Rel_{i,birth} + \sum_k \mu_{1,k} z_{iotk} + \sum_k exp_{otk} + \mu_x X_{iot} + \gamma_o + \gamma_t + v_{iot}$$

where $exp_{otk} = \Delta Price_{kt} \times exposure_{ko}$ is the direct exposure of district o to the commodity k shock.

First stage regressions are reported in tables —.

2.3 Instrument Exogeneity

In order for the instruments to be exogenous, it must be that the instrument only affects religious choice through migration, holding fixed controls. Recent literature in shift-shares has established that consistency can be achieved either through plausible exogeneity of the shifts (Borusyak et al., 2022) or of the shares (Goldsmith-Pinkham et al., 2020). In this section, I will argue that 1) exposure and distance shares are plausibly exogenous, i.e. that trends over time for districts with more or less exposure are the same absent of migration, and 2) that conditional on controls, shocks to employment opportunities in destination districts are randomly assigned across individuals.

I first consider the exposure of districts to shocks in commodity prices. If estimation were to occur at the district level, we would require that the equivalent of a parallel trends assumption; that trends in Pentecostalism over time across districts are the same absent of the price shock. Without controls, this is unlikely to hold. Districts closer to high density Pentecostal districts are likely to experience differential exposure over time, and districts that are more remote are likely to experience less exposure to religious pluralism. To address these issues I firstly control for region-time fixed effects, so that identification occurs by exploiting differences in the within-district exposure to industry shocks. I also control for population density, and access to Pentecostalism, by including a weighted distance measure to districts with Pentecostalism, similar to the construction of the instrument. I also control for initial percentage Pentecostal at baseline. To address concerns that exposure to price shocks is correlated across space I directly control for local district exposure to the price shock ($\Delta Price_{kt} \times exposure_{kd}$) There may also be concerns that price shocks in close by districts have spillover effects, either through trade or existing transfer networks. To address

this I control for average district income. In figure — below I show that districts with similar weights have similar growth patterns given controls.

Having established that the price-exposure measure provides plausibly random variation across districts, I transform this to an individual exposure, by multiplying by an individual productivity weight - the product of years of education at baseline and an age weight, based on the national likelihood of migrating at age a based on statistics from the 2000 Ghana census. I control directly for age and years of education level, so that identification occurs through the differential exposure of age-education individuals to the price shock. However many unobservables may be correlated with age and education that predict Pentecostal affiliation. Income, or fertility, for example, will be correlated with both age and income, and may affect religious choice. Using the approach of (Borusyak et al., 2022), the exclusion restriction then rests on the exposure shocks being as-good-as-randomly-assigned given controls and fixed effects, i.e. that exposure to district shocks does not systematically differ by individual productivity weighting ϕ_{it-1} . In figure — below I compare the distribution of shocks for individuals with high and low ageweights, and high and low education levels, after conditioning on controls and fixed effects. I directly control for income, household size, number of births and number of deaths in the household. The distributions appear very similar, so that individuals with different productivity measures are exposed to similar levels of the shock.

More formally, following Borusyak et al. (2022) I run a set of balance tests, regressing potential confounding factors, including education and age weight, against differences in the shock in a pooled cross-section, controlling for region fixed effects. If the shock is uncorrelated with these confounding factors, then we can conclude the shocks are as-good-as-randomly assigned, and that the shock is not arbitrarily picking up comovements with other individual characteristics.

3 Migration Results

Since the industry shocks I am using, especially in mining and construction will predominantly affect men, and because the majority of migration for women is for marriage or family purposes, I restrict the sample to male migrants. The estimation here is limited by restrictions in the data - though enumerators made attempts to track down migrants across waves, there is significant attrition. I adjust for this attrition using inverse probability weighting based on observables ¹. The results of the instrument regression are presented in table ??.

Columns (1) - (3) are the results for migrants who began in rural areas, and (4) - (6) are the results for migrants who began in urban areas. Male migrants from rural locations are more likely to be Pentecostal after migrating, and less likely to be Protestant. Conversely, male migrants from urban areas are less likely to be Pentecostal after migrating, with some evidence of a shift towards Protestantism.

Table 2

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>					
	<i>Pentecostal</i>	<i>Catholic</i>	<i>Protestant</i>	<i>Pentecostal</i>	<i>Catholic</i>	<i>Protestant</i>
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)	(5)	(6)
<i>Migrate</i>	0.338*** (0.127)	-0.138 (0.105)	-0.340*** (0.114)	-0.292** (0.142)	0.002 (0.075)	0.221 (0.157)
Mean	0.26	0.14	0.16	0.4	0.11	0.24
F^{Eff}	12.8003	12.8003	12.8003	7.3576	7.3576	7.3576
Region-Wave FE	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	4,320	4,320	4,320	2,158	2,158	2,158
Adjusted R ²	0.372	0.353	0.324	0.376	0.342	0.299

A corresponding regression can be run to determine the effect of migrating on conversion - conversion between religions, conversion between denominations or conversion to Pentecostalism. The results are given in table 3. The results show no significant increase in conversion rates for migrants from either rural or urban areas.

In general the results in this section are limited by the relatively small sample size, and the attrition of migrants across waves, so an increase in conversion rate cannot be ruled out. However there may be two forces acting simultaneously which produce this null result - non-Pentecostals may migrate to the city and convert, while Pentecostals upon migrating

¹In most cases, it is known which individuals have migrated, since the household at origin reports their migration event. However, there is no information on the current religious affiliation of migrants that are not tracked down

are less likely to convert. This seems plausible, given the positive sign on the conversion to Pentecostalism regression.

Table 3

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>					
	<i>Conv_{Any}</i>	<i>Conv_{Denom}</i>	<i>Conv_{Pent}</i>	<i>Conv_{Any}</i>	<i>Conv_{Denom}</i>	<i>Conv_{Pent}</i>
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)	(5)	(6)
<i>Migrate</i>	−0.074 (0.116)	0.202 (0.163)	0.048 (0.078)	−0.093 (0.141)	−0.152 (0.143)	−0.074 (0.087)
Mean	0.2	0.27	0.06	0.15	0.24	0.02
<i>F^{Eff}</i>	12.7873	12.7873	12.7873	7.4413	7.4413	7.4413
Region-Wave FE	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	4,317	4,317	4,317	2,157	2,157	2,157
Adjusted R ²	0.178	0.224	0.089	0.146	0.208	0.059

3.1 Migrant Mechanism

3.1.1 Network Services

I now seek to establish the mechanism behind this shift in religious affiliation for migrants moving from rural areas. I provide evidence to support the hypothesis that these migrants join Pentecostal churches for the network services they provide. Firstly, I demonstrate that Pentecostal churches provide economic assistance in the form of transfers significantly more than other religions and denominations.

Table ?? presents summary statistics from the religion unit in the fourth wave of the GSPS survey on both the services received from the religious institution, and contributions made. Table A.4 tests for differences in the provision of services across denominations, controlling for age, gender, household structure, income, and education levels. The significance results are reported in table ??. Pentecostals are significantly more likely than other denominations to report receiving transfers directly from their institution within the previous year. 10% of Pentecostals in urban areas report receiving at least some transfer from their institution within the last year. Pentecostals have the highest coefficient on transfers received from other members of the institution, and in businesses advertised, though these differences are not statistically significant. The second highest level of transfers is provided by religious institutions. There appears to be some selection into Protestant churches. After controlling

for district fixed effects, the coefficient on Protestant reduces and becomes statistically insignificant. I do not include information on job and housing referrals here, since reported referrals are less than one percent in each denomination.

On the other side of the equation, Pentecostals and Protestants appear to be similarly likely to give a set proportion of their income to their religious institution (i.e., to tithe), significantly more than Catholics and non-Christians. Giving and spending outside of this tithe is relatively small, with no significant differences across denomination.

To understand the scale of these services from an institutional standpoint, table 4 reports results from the survey of 35 Pentecostal churches in Accra. Of the 32 churches that responded to the services section of the survey, 31 of them reported giving monetary transfers to their members, with a median of 12 transfers per year. Most also reported in kind transfers in terms of food and clothing. The median size of a transfer is 475 Cedi, representing approximately 1/4 of the median monthly urban household income in our sample (1870 Cedi). In kind transfers tend to be smaller, and to be given to households with lower monthly incomes. The median size of church in the sample is 110, indicating that churches report giving approximately 10% of their members a transfer within a year, in line with the GSPS results. Churches report helping more members to find jobs and housing than reported by individuals in the GSPS. Finally, churches report providing support for businesses started by their members. The reports on advertising opportunities are reflected in the GSPS data, though few people report to having attended business or skills training.

Pentecostal churches, therefore, appear to be providing network related services, especially transfers, in urban areas. Most of these transfers are centralised, and are channelled formally through the organisation. This support is supplemented by transfers that are given informally by members of the same religious institution. Notably, Pentecostal churches are significantly more likely than any other group to provide transfers through the institutional channel. These services come at a cost, with Pentecostal churches requiring greater tithing commitments.

I now examine which migrants convert in the city, and in particular, I test if migrants with fewer connections in the city on arrival are more likely to convert. If Pentecostal churches are providing a doctrine that is particularly appealing to the type of people who

	Number Churches	Mean	Median	Std	Min	Max
Number of Transfers						
Monetary	31	17.15	12	17.06	1	80
Food	26	17.54	10	19.08	2	80
Clothing	22	16.25	10	20.93	1	80
Size of Transfers						
Monetary	31	1749.17	475	2324.41	100	8000
Food	26	765.42	100	1484.98	50	5000
Clothing	22	577	100	1144.35	50	5000
Other Network Services						
Helped find job	28	15	7.50	26.22	2	135
Helped find housing	26	8.46	5	12.82	1	60
Business Related Services						
Business Training (Participation)	16	45.12	30	46.24	3	200
Skills Training (Participation)	16	39.31	28.50	40.66	4	170
Businesses Advertised	25	8.48	5	9.31	1	40

Table 4: Survey of 35 Pentecostal churches in Accra, Ghana: services provided in the previous year.

migrate, we would not expect there to be differential conversion based upon connections at the destination.

To test this, I construct a year-by-year panel for migration using the self-reported migration information from the GSPS. I add a year-by-year panel for conversion, using observed conversion during the years of the Ghana Panel, and self-reports on when individuals converted away from their religion at birth. The construction of the conversion panel will miss conversions if the individual converts multiple times before 2009. The majority of individuals who convert report only converting once in their lifetime. I remove individuals from this estimation who report converting more than once, with these conversions not appearing in the years of the panel ($< 5\%$). Self-reported migration and conversion contains significant reporting error, and in particular, significant bunching of reported migration around 5 year intervals. To address this concern, I look at the effect of migration on conversion in the 5 years following the migration event. I run a fixed effects regression of the following form:

$$Conv_{idt} = \beta_R Rel_{i,birth} + \beta_{M_1} Mig_{NoConn,idt} + \beta_{M_2} Mig_{Conn,idt} + \beta_X X_{idt} + \alpha_i + \alpha_t + \varepsilon_{idt}$$

The results are reported in table . The results demonstrate that in periods where an individual migrates with no connections, they are significantly more likely to convert. Conversely, there is no significant effect of migrating with connections on conversion.

Consistent with these results are several remaining hypotheses. It may be the case that upon migrating, the migrant increases their income, and this increase in income is the factor that leads to conversion. This is inconsistent, however, with the evidence presented for

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>			
	<i>Convert</i>	<i>Convert_{Pent}</i>	<i>Convert</i>	<i>Convert_{Pent}</i>
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)
Know Relative/Acquaintance	−0.002 (0.010)	0.009 (0.010)	−0.008 (0.010)	0.004 (0.009)
Know No One	0.035* (0.018)	0.020 (0.014)	0.037** (0.016)	0.023* (0.013)
Mean	0.19	0.26	0.19	0.26
Ind FE	No	No	Yes	Yes
Observations	128,835	128,835	128,835	128,835
Adjusted R ²	0.069	0.063	0.217	0.227

Table 5: Ghana Panel year by year regression using self-reported migration events. *Convert* is conversion in the 5 year period after migration. *Convert_{Pent}* is conversion to Pentecostalism. Errors clustered at the EA level.*p<0.1; **p<0.05; ***p<0.01

migrants with fewer connections, who are less likely to be employed upon migrating. Table — shows that men who are unemployed upon migrating are more likely to convert. I also conduct a robustness test in table — comparing the effect of income and instrument price changes on conversion for migrants vs non-migrants. I find no evidence for a differential conversion effect of income between migrants and non-migrants. It may be the case that migrants, and especially disenfranchised migrants who have not found employment in the city are especially attracted to the doctrines presented in Pentecostal churches, in providing hope and meaning to their lives. This story would be consistent with the evidence offered by Binzel and Carvalho (2017), where unemployed males in Egypt disappointed with their job market outcomes shift their time use towards religious practices. To test this, I look at the questions related to religious intensity. If disenfranchised migrants are simply becoming more religious, we should see an increase in religiosity outside of interactions with the network, when compared to employed converts. Given religious intensity is only observed at the fourth wave, results here are limited. [could also look at transfers, or interactions with community, or hopelessness/depressed measures] It may also be the case that migrants do value network services, but it is the social, rather than economic component of the network that they value. In this case, there should be no difference in conversion based on economic outcomes in the city. Holding fixed network connections, employment outcomes should not predict conversion.

4 Out-Migration

In this section, I investigate the effect of out-migration on the religious affiliation of households at origin. Outmigration may affect religious affiliation through several channels - a household with an out-migrant may be exposed to a new religion product for the first time, a household with an out-migrant may join the religion of the migrant as a form of support, a household may increase their religiosity as a form of divine investment in the migrant. I test these against the hypothesis that outmigration breaks down the village network as in Morten (2019), and the breaking down of the village network increases the demand for alternative sources of network goods, which are provided by religious institutions.

I run a household equivalent regression to the one used in the section above.

$$Rel_{hodt} = \beta_R Rel_{h,birth} + \beta_M Mig_{hodt} + \sum_k exp_{otk} + \beta_X X_{idt} + \alpha_o + \alpha_t + \varepsilon_{idt}$$

$$M_{iodt} = \beta_R Rel_{i,birth} + \sum_k \mu_{1,k} z_{iotk} + \sum_k exp_{otk} + \mu_x X_{iot} + \gamma_o + \gamma_t + v_{iot}$$

Rel_{hodt} is the number of household members in household h that belong to religion Rel at time t , $Rel_{h,birth}$ is the modal religion of the adult household members at birth, Mig_{hodt} is the number of out-migrants from household h that migrated between periods $t - 1$ and t , α_o is the fixed effect for the community at time 0, and α_t is the time fixed effect.

The instrument is defined using the same industry shocks as in the migration section. The instrument is modified to represent exposure at the household level. The same arguments for exogeneity stand as discussed. The instrument expression becomes

$$z_{hotk} = \phi_{h,0} \sum_{d \in \Theta/o} \frac{\Delta Price_{kt} \times exposure_{kd}}{\tau_{od}}$$

$$\phi_{h,0} = yearsedu_{h,0} \times ageweight_{h,0}$$

where $yearsedu_{h,0}$ is the total years of education for household h at baseline and $ageweight_{h,0}$ is the average age of adults in household h at baseline.

The results of this regression are given in table 6.

Table 6

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>			
	<i>Pentecostal</i>	<i>Catholic</i>	<i>Protestant</i>	<i>Ethnic</i>
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)
Num_{Mig}	0.060** (0.030)	0.106*** (0.032)	0.048** (0.024)	0.149** (0.062)
‘malemig(fit)’	−0.381** (0.178)	−0.060 (0.085)	0.091 (0.182)	0.102 (0.078)
Mean	1.166	0.563	0.554	0.287
F^{Eff}	37.9122	37.9122	37.9122	37.9122
HH Control	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	6,860	6,860	6,860	6,860
Adjusted R ²	0.660	0.703	0.632	0.574

These results show that households with outmigrants are less likely to have Catholic members as a result. Though not significant, Pentecostal also appears to decline, in favor of Protestantism. Running the regression on conversion obtains the results given in table 7. Out migration increases conversion rates between religions and denominations. While conversion rates to Pentecostalism increase, this is evidently less than the conversion away which leads to a net positive for Protestant affiliation.

Table 7

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>		
	<i>Conv_{Rel}</i>	<i>Conv_{Denom}</i>	<i>Conv_{Pent}</i>
	(1)	(2)	(3)
Mig_{Out}	0.280*** (0.065)	0.307*** (0.076)	0.154*** (0.047)
Mean	0.458	0.603	0.141
F^{Eff}	37.9122	37.9122	37.9122
Observations	6,860	6,860	6,860
Adjusted R ²	0.177	0.208	0.016

4.0.1 Out-Migrant Mechanism

In this section, I provide evidence that households are converting in response to a weakening village network, and that Protestant churches are more effective service providers in rural areas.

Table 8 compares services provided by religious institutions in rural areas in the Ghana Panel, with stars representing differences in services provided, or contributions made compared to Catholic affiliated households. Tables A.3 and ?? report the regressions.

		Services Received from Institution				
		From Institution		From Network		
Denomination	N	<i>TransMoney</i>	<i>TransIn-Kind</i>	<i>TransMoney</i>	<i>TransIn-Kind</i>	<i>Advertise</i>
Catholic	843	0.03	0.03	0.01	0.02	0.02
Pentecostal	2102	0.05	0.04	0.03***	0.03	0.03
Protestant	1053	0.04	0.03	0.02	0.02	0.03
Muslim	1189	0.01	0.03	0.00	0.02*	0.02
Traditional	475	0.01	0.01	0.01	0.01	0.01
		Contributions to Institution				
Denomination	N	<i>Tithe</i>	<i>Giving</i>	<i>ReligItems</i>	<i>AttendServices</i>	<i>AttendOther</i>
Catholic	843	0.46	13.23	0.13	69.05	46.49
Pentecostal	2102	0.61***	14.96	0.10	66.42	48.53***
Protestant	1053	0.64***	21.01	0.12	63.86	45.07
Muslim	1189	0.17***	11.44	0.09	242.48***	114.09***
Traditional	475	0.03***	0.65	0.00**	43.47***	34.60 ***

Table 8: Ghana Panel Wave 4 summary statistics - *TransMoney* is a binary variable which takes the value 1 if an individual received a monetary transfer within the last year, *TransIn-kind* is a binary variable which takes the value 1 if an individual received an in-kind transfer within the last year, *Advertise* is a binary variable which takes the value 1 if an individual advertised their business in their religious institution within the last year. *Tithe* is a binary variable which takes the value 1, if the individual reports giving a set portion of their income to their religious institution, *giving* is the amount of giving outside of the tithe, *ReligItems* is the amount spent on purchasing religious materials, *AttendServices* is the number of services attended during the year, and *AttendOther* is attendance at activities outside of the main service. Stars represent the significance for the difference with Catholic following regressions reported in tables A.4 and A.2, *p<0.1; **p<0.05; ***p<0.01.

The results demonstrate no significant differences in the transfers received between any religious group, except that Pentecostals appear to be more likely to receive monetary transfers from their network compared to Catholics. The number of transfers provided to rural households is generally smaller. It seems, therefore, that the Christian denominations resemble each other more strongly in rural areas in terms of the services being provided. Conversely, differences in giving appear even more stark, with Pentecostals and Protestants both much more likely to tithe than their Catholic counterparts. Pentecostal and Protestant groups appear virtually indistinguishable in rural areas.

I now consider what the effect of out-migration is for the relationship between the out-migrant household and their village. The Ghana Panel gathers information both on general trust in the village, and asks specifically about other survey households and their interactions with them. Table ?? reports the effect of migration on the household's trust in the village network. Out migration lowers trust the household trust in the village network, consistent with the story of the breakdown of village networks with migration.

Similarly table ?? reports the change in network interactions following outmigration. Out-migration lowers the number of other village households that the out-migrant household is willing to help, or to share information with.

In both of these cases, important network services, including information are lost as out-

migration occurs. These type of services are provided by religious institutions, suggesting increased religiosity or changed religion may be beneficial for these out-migrant households. Table — reports the results of a regression comparing religiosity for out-migrant and non out-migrant households.

5 Discussion

6 Conclusion

A A nice appendix

Table A.1

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>				
	<i>TransMoney</i>	<i>TransIn-kind</i>	<i>TransMoney</i>	<i>TransIn-kind</i>	Advertise
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)	(5)
Muslim	−0.001 (0.022)	−0.006 (0.020)	−0.009 (0.018)	−0.014 (0.017)	−0.027 (0.020)
Protestant	0.013 (0.018)	0.008 (0.016)	0.001 (0.015)	0.007 (0.014)	−0.0004 (0.017)
Pentecostal	0.036** (0.017)	0.032** (0.015)	0.014 (0.014)	0.016 (0.013)	0.024 (0.016)
Traditional	0.027 (0.042)	−0.013 (0.034)	−0.019 (0.035)	−0.013 (0.029)	−0.023 (0.039)
Constant	0.010 (0.121)	−0.017 (0.096)	0.003 (0.100)	−0.044 (0.082)	−0.041 (0.113)
Mean	0.04	0.05	0.03	0.03	0.04
District FE	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	2,408	3,056	2,407	3,056	2,410
R ²	0.094	0.066	0.122	0.070	0.088
F Statistic	1.461***	1.207**	1.955***	1.295***	1.358***

Table A.2

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>				
	<i>Tithe</i>	<i>Giving</i>	<i>ReligItems</i>	<i>Services</i>	<i>Activity</i>
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)	(5)
Muslim	−0.090* (0.053)	45.585 (37.884)	−0.038 (0.088)	125.492*** (7.954)	85.871*** (7.469)
Protestant	0.227*** (0.042)	−40.414 (30.534)	0.089 (0.071)	2.508 (6.411)	3.549 (6.020)
Pentecostal	0.230*** (0.040)	−22.300 (28.428)	0.015 (0.066)	9.471 (5.969)	6.948 (5.605)
Traditional	−0.360*** (0.088)	−47.859 (65.233)	−0.148 (0.151)	−9.099 (13.697)	2.795 (12.861)
Constant	0.305 (0.265)	−7.763 (183.460)	−0.291 (0.424)	3.336 (38.521)	−18.797 (36.171)
Mean	0.54	67.63	3.15	95.3	NaN
District FE	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	1,861	3,056	3,056	3,056	3,056
R ²	0.301	0.068	0.070	0.436	0.206
F Statistic	4.571***	1.259**	1.297***	13.278***	4.469***

Table A.3

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>				
	<i>Trans_{Money}</i>	<i>Trans_{In-kind}</i>	<i>Trans_{Money}</i>	<i>Trans_{In-kind}</i>	Advertise
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)	(5)
Muslim	-0.007 (0.009)	0.008 (0.010)	0.002 (0.006)	0.019** (0.009)	-0.003 (0.008)
None	-0.020 (0.013)	-0.018 (0.014)	-0.003 (0.009)	-0.019 (0.013)	-0.016 (0.011)
Other	-0.016 (0.057)	-0.011 (0.061)	0.008 (0.040)	0.005 (0.054)	-0.009 (0.049)
Protestant	-0.005 (0.008)	-0.004 (0.008)	-0.004 (0.006)	-0.006 (0.007)	0.003 (0.007)
Renewalist	0.009 (0.007)	0.008 (0.007)	0.013*** (0.005)	0.010 (0.007)	0.006 (0.006)
Traditional	-0.007 (0.011)	-0.002 (0.011)	0.012 (0.007)	0.005 (0.010)	0.004 (0.009)
Constant	-0.002 (0.080)	-0.030 (0.085)	-0.003 (0.056)	-0.029 (0.075)	0.0002 (0.068)
Mean	0.03	0.03	0.01	0.02	0.02
District FE	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	5,853	5,853	5,853	5,853	5,853
R ²	0.060	0.074	0.056	0.081	0.057
F Statistic	1.547***	1.949***	1.439***	2.157***	1.467***

Table A.4

	<i>Dependent variable:</i>				
	<i>Tithe</i>	<i>Giving</i>	<i>ReligItems</i>	<i>Services</i>	<i>Activity</i>
	(1)	(2)	(3)	(4)	(5)
Muslim	-0.166*** (0.032)	2.135 (4.403)	-0.046 (0.042)	134.280*** (4.931)	67.124*** (4.730)
None	-0.363*** (0.043)	-1.953 (6.419)	-0.120** (0.061)	-27.268*** (7.188)	-19.894*** (6.895)
Other	-0.148 (0.251)	-6.552 (27.440)	-0.050 (0.260)	49.638 (30.729)	25.645 (29.475)
Protestant	0.078*** (0.027)	4.059 (3.800)	-0.032 (0.036)	1.240 (4.256)	5.576 (4.082)
Renewalist	0.135*** (0.024)	4.072 (3.317)	-0.019 (0.031)	6.068 (3.715)	9.611*** (3.563)
Traditional	-0.254*** (0.036)	-7.527 (5.050)	-0.101** (0.048)	-30.201*** (5.655)	-18.882*** (5.424)
Constant	0.022 (0.212)	-17.923 (38.099)	2.946*** (0.361)	39.608 (42.666)	46.482 (40.925)
Mean	0.03	0.03	0.01	0.02	0.02
District FE	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes	Yes
Observations	3,379	5,853	5,853	5,853	5,853
R ²	0.353	0.082	0.066	0.497	0.227
F Statistic	7.620***	2.180***	1.715***	24.104***	7.160***

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